

Consumer Valuation of Battery Health Information in Used Electric Vehicle Markets: A Discrete Choice Experiment

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ABSTRACT

This discrete choice experiment (DCE) aimed at understanding consumer preferences and willingness to pay for battery health information in the used battery electric vehicle (BEV) market. The potential survey design includes questions about current vehicle information, future vehicle preferences, a discrete choice experiment (DCE), EV knowledge, and demographics. The DCE systematically varies both standard vehicle attributes (e.g., price, mileage) and battery-specific features (e.g., state-of-health, refurbishment history) to quantify the economic value consumers place on battery-related information. Findings from this research project will improve the understanding of second-life battery markets, and guide future research in the evolving used EV landscape.

1. Introduction

used vehicles make up in the U.S. (Bureau of Transportation Statistics 2023 New and used passenger car and light truck sales and leases (available at: www.bts.gov/content/new-and-used-passenger-car-sales-andleases-thousands-vehicles))

Electric vehicles (EVs) are gaining momentum in the automotive market. While much of the focus of industry professionals and academics has been on promoting new EVs, the used EV market has received comparatively little attention. Meanwhile, the used vehicle market in the U.S. has reached record highs in recent years reaching 70% of all vehicle purchases and is projected to grow steadily over the coming decade (Market Research Future, 2025). As more EVs reach the end of their initial ownership, they are increasingly entering the used market. According to February 2025 sales data (Cox Automotive Inc., 2025), used EV sales rose by 34.2% year-over-year, while the average days' supply fell by 21.5%, signaling strong and accelerating demand.

The growth of the used EV market is crucial from environmental, economic, and market development perspectives. It contributes to a circular economy by extending the useful life of vehicles and batteries, thereby reducing lifecycle emissions (Guzek et al., 2024). Used EVs also lower the financial barriers for middle- and lower-income households to enter the EV market (Hagman et al., 2016), although the affordable models remain relatively limited in availability (Sheykhfard et al., 2025). Furthermore, a healthy resale market boosts value retention of new EVs, enhancing consumer confidence in their long-term investment (Brückmann et al., 2021; Lim et al., 2015).

To support future research and strategy development on the acceptance of used EVs requires a deeper understanding of consumer preferences and concerns. Despite rising supply, consumers still perceive used EVs as scarce in the marketplace (Krishna, 2021). Survey data (Fernandes, 2023) also reflect lingering consumer hesitation: 52% of U.S. adults reported being unlikely to consider buying a used EV, compared to only 28% who were open to the idea. In addition to challenges common to both new and used EV, such as range anxiety, limited charging infrastructure, and high purchase costs (Sheykhfard et al., 2025), used EVs come with added concerns. Key issues include uncertainty about the vehicle history and condition (cited by 41% of respondents in Fernandes' study), as well as perceptions of

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lower reliability compared to new EVs (23%). Based on Sheykhfard et al. (2025), more than half (55.1%) of current used EV owners reported having pre-purchase concerns about battery longevity, primarily due to the perceived risk of frequent and costly battery replacements. However, while nearly two thirds (65.5%) of respondents reported some degree of battery decline over time, only 5.1% experienced a substantial loss in battery performance. Moreover, 39.2% and 26.3% of them indicated they are likely or very likely, respectively, to buy a used BEV in the future. These findings suggest that the pre-purchase concerns appear to be overstated in practice, and most used EV owners had a positive ownership experience.

These studies highlight that the used EV market faces a significant information asymmetry problem centered on battery: the most critical and expensive component affecting a used EV's value, in terms of its unobserved maintenance history, current "State of Health" (SOH), and remaining useful life (RUL). Unlike conventional vehicles, where age and mileage serve as reasonable proxies for engine condition and overall wear (Prieto et al., 2015), the battery degradation path and RUL of the battery can vary substantially even among EVs of the same model year and mileage, making the vehicle's true condition far more difficult to assess and increasing the level of risk in the purchase for consumers. This information gap creates economic inefficiencies. Buyers may undervalue well-maintained EVs or unknowingly overpay for poorly maintained ones. Sellers with well-maintained batteries may struggle to recoup the true value of their vehicles at resale. More broadly, market uncertainty may dampen new EV sales, as buyers hesitate to purchase due to "resale anxiety". Understanding the key determinants of used EV purchase decisions, particularly for battery electric vehicles (BEVs), and how consumers evaluate battery health information is critical for policymakers, industry stakeholders, and researchers. This study would be the first attempt to quantify the economic value consumers place on battery health information (i.e., WTP) in the used BEV market. At the core of the study is a discrete choice experiment (DCE), which presents respondents with repeated choices between hypothetical used BEVs. Drawing on insights from the existing literature, the research team identifies key factors influencing used BEV adoption. The DCE systematically varies both conventional vehicle attributes (e.g., mileage, purchase price) and battery-specific attributes (e.g., range, refurbishment history, SOH) to determine which characteristics most influence consumer preferences and to estimate their WTP for specific aspects of battery performance. Ultimately, this study supports future advancements in BEV technology, the effective communication of critical battery information at the point of sale, and a better understanding of consumer priorities, demographic differences, and decision-making factors in the used BEV market.

The remainder of the paper is structured as follows. Section 2 provides a review of literature on household vehicle composition and usage (among BEV users), as well as factors influencing BEV adoption. Section 3 provides an overview of the survey data, and presents both descriptive statistics and comparative analyses. Section 4 outlines the statistical method employed in the analysis. Section 5 presents the key findings, discusses their implications, outlines study limitations, and suggests directions for future research. Finally, Section 6 concludes the paper.

2. Literature Review

This section reviews key literature informing survey design and analyses of this study. The first subsection examines the main drivers and barriers to the adoption of used BEVs, while the second subsection focuses on EV battery technology and how it shapes consumer perceptions and decision-making.

2.1. Used Electric Vehicle Adoption

Gore et al. (2024) provided a comprehensive review on consumer perspectives on EVs and the factors influencing EV adoption, identifying a broad range of determinants including attitudinal, demographic, societal, environmental, technological, and economic variables (Iogansen et al., 2023; Naseri et al., 2024; Sonar et al., 2023). However, most existing studies focused on new EV markets, with comparatively limited attention given to the used EV markets, which is rapidly expanding and playing an increasingly important role in the broader diffusion of electric mobility.

Though some preferences may carry over between new and used vehicle buyers—for instance, longer driving range consistently correlates with stronger EV preference—emerging evidence suggests that these two consumer groups differ in meaningful ways. For instance, used EV buyers are more sensitive to the availability of public charging infrastructure than new EV buyers, likely due to lower rates of home charging access (Zou et al., 2020). Moreover, purchasing behavior for used vehicles is often more risk-averse and budget-conscious, reflecting different decision-making processes than those found in the new car market. This indicates that used EV adoption is not simply a scaled-down version of new EV adoption and warrants independent investigation. Several studies have begun to profile the typical used EV buyer. Canepa et al. (2019) found that used car buyers are commonly cost-conscious. Compared to

the general population, used EV buyers are more likely to be younger, male, White, and better educated. However, compared to those new-EV buyers, used EV buyers tend to have lower household incomes and be renters, with lower access to private garages with EV chargers (Khaloei et al., 2020; Sheykhfard et al., 2025). These characteristics differ from the traditional early adopter profile seen in the new EV market (typically wealthier, homeowners with garages), suggesting that used EVs may serve as a more accessible entry point into EV ownership for broader population segments.

Although range is a common concern for EV users, Sheykhfard et al. (2025) found that the majority of used EV owners drive well within the range capabilities of most existing EV models: 59.4% reported driving fewer than 100 miles per day and 29.4% drove less than 50 miles per day. This implies that range anxiety may be less of a barrier for used EV buyers, who tend to have shorter commutes or use their vehicles in more limited travel contexts. Therefore, range may serve as a less decisive factor in used EV adoption compared to other attributes such as battery condition, charging accessibility, and price.

Electric Vehicle Battery Technology and Consumer Perception The electric vehicle batteries (EVBs) present new risks and opportunities for consumers and the automotive industry. Despite progress in battery technology, consumer concerns about battery health, replacement cost, and resale value persist, especially in the used EV market. A major concern is battery cost, which can represent up to 30% of an EV's total price (Boudway, 2020). Because of this, battery longevity and reliability play a crucial role in determining the economic viability of EV ownership and attractiveness of used EV.

2.2. Battery Degradation and State-of-Health

In the adoption literature, battery-related considerations for BEVs have largely centered on driving range (Yuan et al., 2018). Similarly, the common hesitation among prospective used EV buyers stems from battery degradation, SOH uncertainty and the unreliability of older technology (Pedrosa and Nobre, 2018). Battery degradation is typically manifested by a decrease in energy capacity, driving range, and increased charging time over time (Attia et al., 2022). The rate of degradation depends on multiple factors, including charging patterns (e.g., fast versus slow charging, charging frequency), driving patterns, depth of discharge cycles, and operation conditions (e.g., climate and temperature exposure) (Bashash et al., 2011; Neubauer et al., 2012). Yang et al. (2018) suggests that the BEV batteries can last five years to thirteen years depending on the climate. Studies suggest that battery aging trajectories are often linear or sublinear, meaning that the degradation either occurs at a constant rate or a reduced rate over time, likely due to the stabilization of battery chemistry after initial use (Attia et al., 2022, 2020). Batteries are generally considered to reach their End-of-Life (EoL) for vehicle use when their SOH drops to approximately 70–80% of the original capacity (Canals Casals et al., 2022, 2019). Battery degradation has been shown to reduce consumers' perceived future value of the vehicle and heighten resale anxiety.

2.3. Battery Replacement, Cost, and Warranty Considerations

While the existing literature has considered the longevity of the batteries when calculating the overall cost of EVs (Hagman et al., 2016; Letmathe and Soares, 2017), there is a lack of studies that directly examined the cost of EVBs. Most modern EVBs are designed to last the lifetime of the vehicle under normal use. Dnistran (2024) studied almost 5,000 EVs and revealed that the average annual degradation rate to be just 1.8%, making the battery lifespan often outlasts the vehicle's useful life. However, Sheykhfard et al. (2025) report that although battery performance loss to the point that they need to be replaced are rare but can be expensive. Drawing from real-world experience compiled from a few online sources, the replacement costs can range between \$5,000 and \$20,000 or more depending on the vehicle model and labor (Kothari, 2024; Witt, 2024).

To improve consumer confidence, most EV manufacturers offer warranties covering 8 years or 100,000 miles — whichever comes first (Clarke, 2024). This suggests that consumer purchase intentions can be closely linked to how long they expect to keep the vehicle and whether the battery's SOH will fall below the threshold (70% 75%) within the ownership window. Hitting this threshold can trigger a free battery replacement, which adds economic value and reassurance. This is supported by prior literature suggesting that the cost of BEVs varies widely by how long someone is expected to own the vehicle (Hagman et al., 2016). Letmathe and Soares (2017) also specifically consider reselling the battery separately from the resale cost of the vehicle when calculating the total cost of ownership .

Second-Life and Refurbished Batteries As the number of used EVBs increases, opportunities for reuse and recycling become critical components of a circular battery economy (Skeete et al., 2020; Tankou et al., 2023). Many circular business models emphasize two main second-life pathways for EVBs: one is to exploit deteriorated batteries

for less demanding applications, such as stationary energy storage for homes or grids (Christensen et al., 2021), and the other one is to refurbish those batteries and reintegrate into the EV market. This review focuses on the latter — refurbishing batteries for continued use in EVs.

Refurbishing batteries at the cell or module level can offer cost savings and support the economic viability of BEVs. For example, Jiao and Evans (2016) suggest that repurposing EoL EVBs could reduce the cost differential between BEVs and conventional vehicles. Similarly, Shaikh et al. (2023) conducted a simulation showing that refurbished EVBs are more affordable than new ones. Moreover, the refurbishment costs are lowest when batteries are sold locally, compared to regional and national markets. These findings indicate clear advantages for both automotive manufactures and customers. However, existing studies on second-life EVBs have largely focused on technical and economic feasibility, often outside of the US contexts where EV penetration is higher and EoL battery volumes are projected to increase significantly. In contrast, relatively little attention has been paid to consumer preferences and WTP for refurbished EVBs, which are essential to the success of refurbishment-based business models.

One of the few relevant studies, conducted by Pedrosa and Nobre (2018) in Portugal found that all interviewees expressed positive attitudes toward refurbished EVs, particularly those fitted with replacement batteries backed by dealership warranties. Participants viewed these vehicles as more reliable, with the potential for extended driving range and greater peace of mind, and even indicated a higher WTP compared to used EVs retaining their original batteries. The main limitation of this study is that it is a qualitative interview based on a very small sample and may not be generalizable to the US market. Moreover, while the study suggests a consumer preference for BEVs with brand-new batteries than original ones, to the best of the authors' knowledge, no studies have directly examined consumer attitudes towards more nuanced refurbishment options, such as partial battery replacements where only some cells are replaced to address performance issues or extend battery life while the rest cells remain original, or full pack replacements where the entire battery is swapped with a new pack after the original battery's performance declines below a certain threshold. Understanding consumer acceptance of these varying levels of refurbishment is essential for informing viable second-life battery strategies in the used EV market.

2.4. Willness to Pay for Battery Information

To be continued.

3. Survey Design, Data Collection, and Sample Profile

3.1. Nationwide Used EV Survey

The survey was designed to understand consumer preferences and willingness to pay for vehicle attributes and battery health information in the used BEV market. The survey targets on US consumers who is 18 years old and has the intention to purchase a used car or SUV within the next two years.

The core component of the survey is the BEV discrete choice experiments where respondents are asked to consider a scenario in which they choose a used BEV from a set of options with varying attributes. It is designed to capture trade-offs that consumers make when evaluating used BEVs, particularly how they value battery health information relative to other vehicle attributes. Each respondent completes six repeated choice tasks. Before presenting the choice tasks, we introduce the specific attributes of the BEVs that respondents will evaluate in the upcoming choice experiments (see Table 1). Based on prior studies, age and mileage are the main factors influencing the value of a used car (Prieto et al., 2015). For all choice questions, we ask respondents to assume the used vehicle was built in 2022 and is currently three years old. The attributes with varying values include vehicle mileage, purchase price, battery refurbishment history, electric range, and battery SOH. Note that during the design phase of the discrete choice experiments, we used driving range at year 0 and annual degradation rate to vary the attributes, but for easier understanding for the respondents, we presented the driving range and SOH at year 3 (at the point of purchase), and at year 8 (five years after purchase) in the survey. All attribute descriptions are provided to ensure respondents clearly understand the meaning of each before making their selections.

To examine the effects of information treatment, specifically, how the presentation of certain information may influence consumer preferences, participants are randomly divided into two groups. One group receives only information about vehicle driving range and battery health, while the other group is shown additional details about battery maintenance and warranty coverage. This design allows us to assess whether specific types of information impact respondents' choices in the BEV selection tasks. Figure 1 provides an example of the choice experiment, where respondents are asked to choose between three used BEVs with varying attributes and a "None of the above" option.

Table 1
BEV choice experiment attributes and levels.

Attribute	Definition	Levels			
		Low-budget (≤\$20K) Car	High-budget (>\$20K) Car	Low-budget (≤\$20K) SUV	High-budget (>\$20K) SUV
Mileage	The total number of miles a vehicle has traveled since manufacture.	15,000–60,000 miles, in increments of 500 miles.			
Battery refurbishment history	The repair or replacement work that has been performed on the vehicle's main battery pack.	<i>(1) Original:</i> The battery remains in its factory-original condition with no repairs or replacements. <i>(2) Some battery cells replaced:</i> A portion of the battery cells has been replaced to address performance issues or extend battery life; the remaining cells are original. <i>(3) Entire battery pack replaced:</i> The full battery pack has been replaced with a new, refurbished, or used pack, typically after battery performance declined below a specified threshold.			
Electric range at delivery (Year 0)	The maximum distance the vehicle can travel on a full battery charge under typical driving conditions, as rated at the time of manufacture.	50–150 miles (50-mile increments)	100–250 miles (50-mile increments)	150–250 miles (50-mile increments)	200–350 miles (50-mile increments)
Battery annual degradation rate and state of health (SOH)	The average annual percentage loss in electric range and battery SOH. The remaining range and SOH at Year 3 (current) and Year 8 (five years from purchase) are derived from this rate.	1%–8%, in increments of 1%.			
Purchase price	The total cost of the vehicle in dollars, including down payment, monthly payments, taxes, and fees.	\$10,000–\$20,000 (\$2,000 increments)	\$20,000–\$40,000 (\$5,000 increments)	\$15,000–\$25,000 (\$2,000 increments)	\$25,000–\$45,000 (\$5,000 increments)

Assume you are able to purchase a 3-year-old used vehicle that looks like the one you selected (see photo). Which of the following versions of that vehicle would you be most likely to purchase? Please compare the key features shown for each option before making your selection.



Figure 1: Example of a choice experiment.

1 In addition to DCEs, the survey gather information on a range of other topics. Before the DCEs, The survey
2 collects information on household's current vehicle fleet and detailed vehicle attributes for their primary vehicle if
3 they report owning or leasing at least one (fuel type, fuel efficiency, range,new/used, way of obtain, purchase/lease
4 price,monthly payment,refuel/recharge frequency), and their future vehicle purchasing plans and preferences (antici-
5 pated budget,payment method, andthe likelihood of purchasing a new or used plug-in hybrid or BEV). After the DCEs,
6 the survey assesses respondents' knowledge, attitudes, and perceptions related to EVs, battery technologies, and related
7 topics. It begins with a series of factual questions that evaluate understanding of which vehicles can run on gasoline
8 or be plugged in, whether respondents can name a BEV, and their knowledge of the current U.S. federal tax credit
9 for new EV purchases. Respondents then rate their agreement with a series of attitudinal statements in 5-point Likert
10 scale covering topics such as social norms, environmental beliefs, cost perceptions, battery concerns, and personality
11 traits like risk-taking and price sensitivity. Specifically, these two statements regarding EV batteries are particularly
12 relevant: "Purchasing refurbished EV batteries will minimize negative effects on natural ecosystems." (referred as
13 "environmentally positive") and "Refurbished EV batteries do NOT perform and function as original EV batteries."
14 (referred as "functionally negative").

15 The final section of the survey collects demographic and additional attitudinal information. It includes standard
16 demographic questions such as year of birth, gender, race/ethnicity, household size, income, education level, employ-
17 ment status, and housing type. These variables are crucial for understanding how socio-demographic factors influence
18 preferences and attitudes toward EVs. Additional questions explore home ownership and average electricity bills,
19 factors that may shape EV adoption decisions.

20 For a comprehensive description of the survey design, see the Data Collection Instrument (Gore et al., 2026).⁷

21 **3.2. Data Collection and Sample Profile**

22 The survey was administered online through two widely-used online research platforms. The data collection took
23 place between December 2025 and April 2026. The median survey time is around 14 minutes. The survey participants
24 were compensated through the research platforms.

25 The total respondents collected are 3,657 participants across the US. We apply multiple data quality screens to
26 identify and remove low-quality responses, including speeders and straightliners fo the discrete choice experiments,
27 failure of an embedded attention check, inconsistency between reported information in different sections of the survey,
28 uninformative filler text and gibberish in open-ended responses, and so forth. In the end, the final sample size for this
29 analysis is 2,916 respondents (with 17,508 choice observations). The geographic distribution of respondents is shown
30 in Figure 2. Each point represents a ZIP code, with color and size scaled to respondent count.

⁷The Data Collection Instrument was published prior to the start of data collection. Certain aspects of the survey design were revised following piloting. Where discrepancies exist between the instrument and the present paper, the description in this paper reflects the final implemented version.

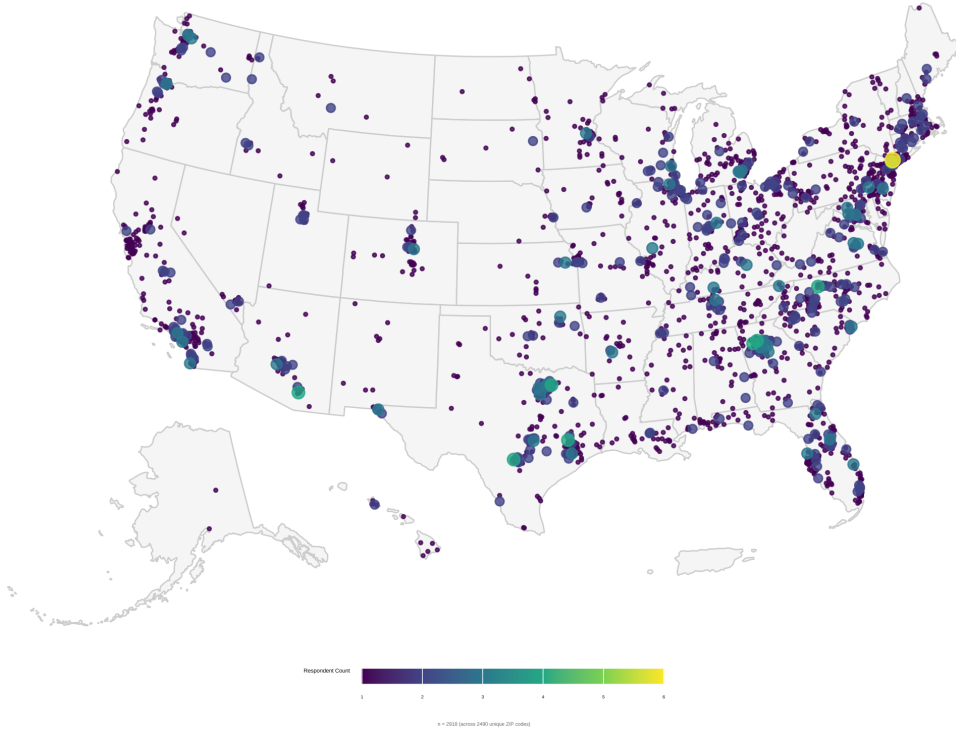


Figure 2: Geographic distribution of survey respondents across the continental United States.

4. Method

4.1. Mixed Logit Model

We started by estimating WTP for changes in vehicle attributes among the full sample to reveal whether there are preferences heterogeneous in vehicle choices in the population level and if yes, by how much. We estimate Mixed Logit (MXL) model directly in the *WTP space*. The MXL model relaxes the Independence of Irrelevant Alternatives (IIA) assumption of the standard Multinomial Logit (MNL) model by allowing preference parameters to vary continuously across individuals (McFadden and Train, 2000; Train, 2009). The WTP space model allows us to specify the WTP for all non-price attributes follows a certain distribution. In this study, we assumed the random parameters follow normal distributions, namely symmetric heterogeneity, since different individuals might attribute higher or lower importance to different vehicle attributes. Following is the utility parameterization following the same notation as in Helveston et al. (2018) and Helveston (2023).

The WTP-space utility for respondent n choosing alternative i in choice scenario t is:

$$u_{nti} = \lambda_n (\omega_n^T \mathbf{x}_{nti} - p_{nti}) + \varepsilon_{nti}, \quad \varepsilon_{nti} \sim \text{Gumbel}\left(0, \frac{\pi^2}{6}\right) \quad (1)$$

where $\mathbf{X}_{pti}$ is a vector of observed vehicle price presented in scenario t to respondent n ; $\mathbf{X}_{nti}$ is a vector of observed BEV attributes including vehicle mileage, battery refurbishment status, current driving range at the point of purchase (at year 3) and estimated range loss rate over the next 5 years (by at year 8)⁸; $\lambda_n > 0$ is the individual-specific scale parameter, ω_n is the vector of individual WTP values drawn from a mixing distribution $f(\omega | \mu, \Sigma)$ with population mean μ and covariance Σ representing the marginal WTP for changes in each non-price attribute, ε_{nti} is an IID Type I

⁸Note that we tested several different model specifications regarding range and battery health: (a1) range at year 0 and annual degradation rate, (a2) range at year 3 and annual degradation rate, (b1) range at year 0 and range loss between year 0 to year 8 in absolute terms, (b2) range at year 3 and range loss between year 3 to year 8 in absolute terms, (c1) range at year 0 and range loss rate between year 0 to year 8 in percentage, (c2) range at year 3 and range loss rate between year 3 to year 8 in percentage. By comparing the model fit and interpretation, (c2) specification performed best and thus is used in our analysis. This indicates that consumers focus more on the current and the relative changes in range and battery health over time.

1 Extreme Value error, and λ represents the scale of the deterministic portion of utility relative to the standardized scale
 2 of the random error term. Because λ_n and ω_n are unobserved, the choice probability is obtained by integrating the logit
 3 kernel over the joint mixing distribution:

$$P_{nti}(\mu, \Sigma) = \int \int \frac{\exp(\lambda(\omega^\top \mathbf{x}_{nti} - p_{nti}))}{\sum_j \exp(\lambda(\omega^\top \mathbf{x}_{ntj} - p_{ntj}))} f(\omega \mid \mu, \Sigma) g(\lambda) d\omega d\lambda \quad (2)$$

4 This integral is evaluated by simulation using Halton draws ($R=500$ in our case). Accounting for the panel structure
 5 of repeated choice tasks per respondent ($T=6$), the simulated log-likelihood is:

$$\mathcal{L}(\mu, \Sigma) = \sum_{n=1}^N \ln \left[\frac{1}{R} \sum_{r=1}^R \prod_{t=1}^T \frac{\exp(\lambda_r(\omega_r^\top \mathbf{x}_{nti^*} - p_{nti^*}))}{\sum_j \exp(\lambda_r(\omega_r^\top \mathbf{x}_{ntj} - p_{ntj}))} \right] \quad (3)$$

6 where (λ_r, ω_r) is the r -th draw from the joint mixing distribution, and i_{nt}^* is the alternative chosen by respondent n
 7 in scenario t . Because estimation is carried out directly in WTP space, the population mean WTP for each non-price
 8 attribute k is obtained directly as $\hat{\mu}_k$ from the estimated distribution of ω_n , without requiring any post-estimation ratio
 9 transformation. We estimate the model using the *logitr* R package (Helsevst, 2023).

10 4.2. Latent Class Choice Model

11 Model Framework

12 As we will see in the 5 section, we observe a large degree of preference heterogeneity across respondents. Therefore,
 13 we employ a Latent Class Choice Model(LCCM) to better understand the underlying preference structure. The LCCM
 14 is built on the premise that individuals can be grouped into a finite number of latent groups/segments/classes, within
 15 which individuals share homogeneous preferences, but across which preferences are heterogeneous (Greene and
 16 Hensher, 2003; Kamakura and Russell, 1989). This approach is particularly suited to our research context, where
 17 consumer valuations of battery health information likely differ systematically across distinct segments varied by
 18 individual characteristics.

19 As illustrated in Figure 3, the LCCM consists of two interrelated components which are estimated simultaneously.
 20 The *class membership model* assigns each respondent probabilistically to a latent class based on observable individual-
 21 level covariates and the *class-specific choice model* estimates the conditional probability of choosing each vehicle
 22 alternative within a given class. Additionally, a set of *inactive indicators*, including attitudinal and behavioral variables,
 23 though not directly included as estimators (due to collinearity, insignificance, or theoretical considerations), are used to
 24 further descriptively characterize the identified latent classes after estimation. The mathematical details of the LCCM
 25 are as follows, with notations consistent with Chen et al. (2023).

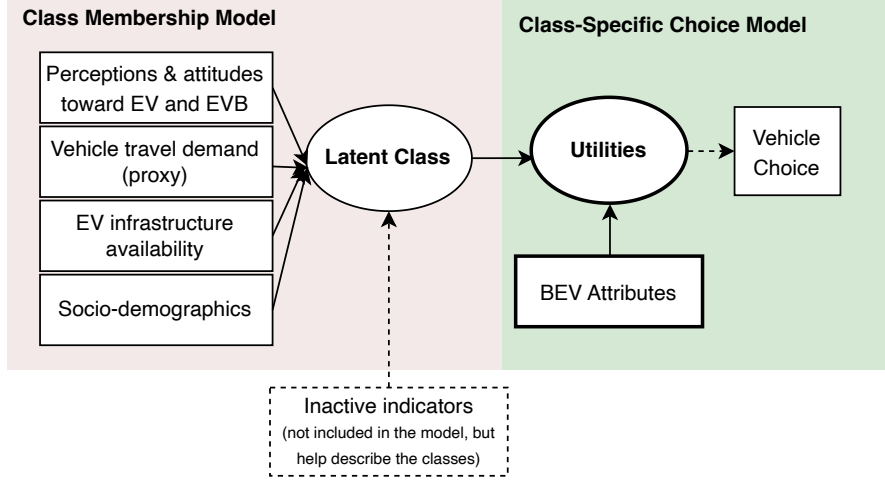


Figure 3: LCCM model framework.

Class-specific Choice Model

For respondent n belonging to latent class s ($s = 1, 2, \dots, S$), the utility associated with choosing vehicle alternative i in choice scenario t ($t = 1, 2, \dots, 6$) is specified as:

$$U_{nti|s} = \beta'_s \mathbf{X}_{nti} + \varepsilon_{nti|s} \quad (4)$$

where $\mathbf{X}_{nti}$ is a vector of observed BEV attributes presented in scenario t to respondent n ; β_s is a vector of class-specific utility parameters capturing the marginal utility of each attribute for class s ; and $\varepsilon_{nti|s}$ is a random error term assumed to be an IID Type I Extreme Value (Gumbel) distribution. Under this assumption, the conditional probability that respondent n in class s chooses alternative i in scenario t follows the MNL form:

$$P_{nt}(i | s) = \frac{\exp(\beta'_s \mathbf{X}_{nti})}{\sum_{j \in C_{nt}} \exp(\beta'_s \mathbf{X}_{ntj})} \quad (5)$$

where C_{nt} denotes the choice set available to respondent n at scenario t .

including vehicle mileage, battery refurbishment status, estimated driving range and battery SOH currently (at years 3) and in the future (at year 8; 5 years from now), and purchase price

To test the non-linear relationship between key attributes (i.e., range) and choice probability, we consider two alternative specifications: a quadratic model and a piecewise linear model. Consumers likely have diminishing sensitivity to range at high levels and heightened sensitivity around critical thresholds (e.g., range anxiety kicks in hard below certain miles).

The quadratic model allows curvature but forces a symmetric parabolic shape and can behave poorly at the tails. The piecewise model instead estimates a separate slope for each segment, allowing flexible, asymmetric nonlinearity with directly interpretable coefficients. After testing both specifications, we find that the piecewise linear model provides a better fit to the data and more meaningful insights into consumer preferences, so we adopt the piecewise specification in our final model. The piecewise linear specification are defined based on the following breakpoints based on both theoretical considerations and empirical patterns observed in the data: range at year 3 (<130 miles, 130-200 miles, >200 miles) and range loss rate (<12%, 12%-24%, >25%).

Class Membership Model

The class membership model specifies the probability that respondent n belongs to latent class s as a function of observed individual-level covariates. The class membership probability is:

$$M_n(s) = \frac{\exp(\gamma'_s \mathbf{Z}_n)}{\sum_{s'=1}^S \exp(\gamma'_{s'} \mathbf{Z}_n)} \quad (6)$$

where $\mathbf{Z}_n$ is a vector of individual-level covariates comprising four groups: (1) *perceptions and attitudes toward EVs and EV batteries* (e.g., range anxiety, environmental impact and functionality of EVB); (2) *vehicle travel demand proxies* (e.g., range of individual's primary vehicle); (3) *EV infrastructure availability* (e.g., access to electrical outlets); and (4) *socio-demographic characteristics* (e.g., income). γ_s is the vector of membership function parameters for class s . To ensure identification, the parameters for the reference class S are normalized to zero.

The unconditional probability that respondent n chooses alternative i in scenario t , integrated over all latent classes, is:

$$P_{nt}(y_n = i) = \sum_{s=1}^S P_{nt}(i | s) \cdot M_n(s) \quad (7)$$

Substituting Equations (5) and (6) into Equation (7), the full integrated choice probability is:

$$P_{nt}(y_n = i) = \sum_{s=1}^S \left[\frac{\exp(\beta'_s \mathbf{X}_{nti})}{\sum_{j \in C_{nt}} \exp(\beta'_s \mathbf{X}_{ntj})} \cdot \frac{\exp(\gamma'_s \mathbf{Z}_n)}{\sum_{s'=1}^S \exp(\gamma'_{s'} \mathbf{Z}_n)} \right] \quad (8)$$

The log-likelihood function across all N respondents and T choice scenarios is:

$$\mathcal{L}(\beta, \gamma) = \sum_{n=1}^N \sum_{t=1}^T \ln P_{nt}(y_n = i_n^*) \quad (9)$$

where i_n^* denotes the alternative chosen by respondent n in scenario t . The model parameters β_s and γ_s are estimated jointly via maximum likelihood estimation.

Willingness to Pay

A key output of the LCCM is class-specific WTP for each BEV attribute. Under the assumption that the marginal utility of price is negative and constant across alternatives, the WTP for attribute k in class s is:

$$\text{WTP}_{s,k} = -\frac{\hat{\beta}_{s,k}}{\hat{\beta}_{s,\text{price}}} \quad (10)$$

This quantity represents the maximum dollar amount a representative respondent in class s would be willing to pay (or accept as compensation) for a one-unit improvement in attribute k , holding all other attributes constant.

5. Results and Discussion

5.1. Results of Mixed Logit Model

Table 2 presents the estimated parameters for the mixed logit model. All mean WTP parameters are significant at $p < 0.001$. On average, respondents value additional range at \$11,160 per unit (Year 3), penalize higher mileage at

\$2,810 per 10,000 miles, and discount range loss rate at \$1,000 per percentage of degradation. Both refurbishment types carry similar disutility (\$4,010 for pack replacement; \$4,470 for cell replacement), and the no-choice option imposes a strong opt-out penalty of \$51,910.

The standard deviation estimates reveal substantial heterogeneity in all five random parameters. Range (Year 3) exhibits the largest absolute spread ($SD = 1.398^{***}$, relative to a mean of 1.113), with simulated WTP draws ranging from a first quartile of \$1,720 to a third quartile of \$20,540, indicating that a non-trivial share of respondents place little value on range while others value it very highly. Heterogeneity is also pronounced for the refurbishment attributes: the standard deviations for pack replacement ($SD = 0.754^{***}$) and cell replacement ($SD = 0.678^{***}$) are larger in magnitude than the respective means, with third-quartile draws turning positive (\$1,060 and \$120 respectively), suggesting that roughly one quarter of respondents view battery refurbishment neutrally or as a positive quality signal (in lieu of for a better price). Mileage also displays substantial dispersion ($SD = 0.404^{***}$), with approximately a quarter of the simulated distribution crossing zero. In contrast, range loss rate is the most uniformly negative attribute: its standard deviation ($SD = 0.079^{***}$) is smaller relative to the mean, and the draw distribution remains negative across nearly the entire sample (third quartile: \$470 disutility per percentage). Taken together, these results confirm significant preference heterogeneity in the population and motivate the latent class analysis reported in the following section.

Table 2
Mixed Logit Model Estimates in WTP Space (price unit: \$10,000).

Parameter	Estimate	Std. Error	<i>p</i> -value					
<i>Mean parameters</i>					<i>Summary of 10k Draws</i>			
					1st Qu.	Median	3rd Qu.	
	λ (scale)	0.980	0.025	<0.001	***			
	Mileage	-0.280	0.015	<0.001	***	-0.552	-0.280	-0.008
	Range (Year 3)	1.114	0.046	<0.001	***	0.172	1.113	2.054
	Range loss Rate (Year 3 to Year 8, in percentage)	-0.100	0.003	<0.001	***	-0.153	-0.100	-0.047
	Battery Refurbishment: Pack Replace	-0.401	0.038	<0.001	***	-0.911	-0.402	0.106
	Battery Refurbishment: Cell Replace	-0.448	0.038	<0.001	***	-0.904	-0.447	0.011
	No choice (opt-out)	-5.187	0.114	<0.001	***			
<i>Standard deviation</i>								
SD: Mileage	-0.404	0.017	<0.001	***				
SD: Range (Year 3)	1.396	0.055	<0.001	***				
SD: Range loss Rate (Year 3 to Year 8, in percentage)	-0.079	0.003	<0.001	***				
SD: Battery Refurbishment: Pack Replace	0.754	0.061	<0.001	***				
SD: Battery Refurbishment: Cell Replace	-0.678	0.063	<0.001	***				
Observations					2,916 $\times$ 6 = 17,496			
Parameters					12			
Log-Likelihood					-17,647.52			
Null Log-Likelihood					-24,254.61			
AIC					35,319.03			
BIC					35,412.27			
McFadden R^2					0.2724			
Adj. McFadden R^2					0.2719			

Signif. codes: 0 '***' 0.001 '**' 0.01 '*' 0.05 '.' 0.1.

5.2. Results of Latent Class Choice Model

5.2.1. Model Selection

To determine the optimal number of classes, we estimated models ranging from one to eight classes (see Table 3). We eventually opted for a six-class solution based on their model fit measured by log-likelihood (LL), LL^2 , Akaike Information Criterion (AIC), Bayesian Information Criterion (BIC), Adjusted ρ^2 , entropy, class proportion, and interpretability. Smaller values of AIC , BIC , together with larger Adjusted ρ^2 and Entropy, indicate better model fit

1 and class separation (Nylund et al., 2007). Additionally, in the 7- and 8- cluster solutions, one class would contain less
2 than 6% of the sample, making it less robust for further analyses.

Table 3
Latent Class Model Fit Index Comparison.

No. of Classes	Npar	LL	L^2	AIC	BIC	Adj. ρ^2	Entropy	Class proportions
1	11	-20,474	0	40,970	41,056	0.148	—	100.0%
2	33	-17,917	5,114	35,901	36,157	0.254	0.911	78.8% / 21.2%
3	55	-17,411	6,126	34,931	35,358	0.274	0.759	56.0% / 23.4% / 20.6%
4	77	-17,071	6,806	34,296	34,895	0.287	0.758	47.7% / 21.9% / 21.6% / 8.8%
5	99	-16,771	7,406	33,740	34,510	0.299	0.723	25.8% / 22.9% / 21.5% / 21.1% / 8.7%
6	121	-16,538	7,872	33,318	34,258	0.308	0.730	22.7% / 20.8% / 18.5% / 16.6% / 12.8% / 8.7%
7	143	-16,413	8,122	33,113	34,224	0.312	0.736	22.2% / 18.3% / 16.5% / 15.9% / 12.6% / 8.8% / 5.6%
8	165	-16,308	8,332	32,947	34,229	0.316	0.728	20.4% / 16.1% / 16.0% / 15.1% / 12.8% / 7.9% / 5.8% / 5.8%

¹ $L^2 = -2(LL_{lc} - LL_{model})$.

² Adj. ρ^2 = adjusted rho-squared vs. observed shares (constants model).

³ Entropy = $1 - H/H_{max}$, where $H = -\sum \pi_{ik} \log(\pi_{ik})$. Values closer to 1 indicate cleaner class separation.

5.2.2. WTP and Class Profiles

4 Estimated model coefficients are presented in Table 4, with **Class 1** as the reference class. WTP estimates and
5 class profiles are reported in Table 5, and Figure 4 provides a visual overview of the WTP patterns and profiles across
6 classes. In addition, Table 6 provides additional information regarding response patterns of each class.

7 Overall, we can roughly segment six classes into two groups: attribute-sensitive groups (including Class 2, 3, and 5)
8 and attribute-insensitive groups (including Class 1, 4, and 6). The following subsections provide detailed descriptions
9 of each class. Class 1, the most BEV-skeptical class is introduced first as an anchor, with other classes introduced in
10 an order that highlights their unique WTP patterns and profiles, as well as the flow of description.

Class 1: Opt-Out Dominant, BEV-Skeptical ($n=252$, 8.7%).

12 Class 1 is defined primarily by systematic opt-out behavior: 75.4% of members selected the non-choice option in all six
13 choice tasks, and 19.4% did so in five of six. As a result, their WTP estimates for vehicle attributes are economically
14 small and largely insignificant, with the exception of marginal utility of high range vehicle (200+ miles) as well as
15 disutility for range loss (\$1.6k* per % within 5-12% rate) and battery refurbishment (\$6.4k* pack replacement, \$7.3k*
16 cell replacement).

17 Class 1 represents respondents who have are not yet viable participants in the used-BEV market. The majority
18 (70.4%) strongly disagree with the likelihood of purchasing a used BEV. Their characteristics are consistent with the
19 descriptions from prior literature about non-BEV adopters and BEV-skeptical. They are the oldest on average (47.1
20 years), and least risk-taking (24.0%) and environmentally conscious. They are dominately internal combustion engine
21 vehicle (ICEV) users (89.3% of the household only has ICEVs and 93.3% drive an ICEV as the primary vehicle).
22 Higher proportion (68.2%) of the individuals consider an SUV as the next vehicle. They report the lowest knowledge
23 on EVs (68.5%) and EV subsidies (10.6%), yet the highest rate of EV range anxiety (87.2%). They hold the negative
24 attitudes towards refurbished EV batteries: only 30.5% agree that they are environmentally positive, and merely 9.1%
25 disagree that they are functionally negative. In terms of infrastructure readiness and EV neighborhood effect (Iogansen
26 et al., 2023), they have the lowest electrical outlet access (32.8%) and lowest EV exposure (24.7%).

Class 3: Range focused, EV-ready ($n=485$, 16.6%).

28 Class 3 appears to be the opposite of the Class 1 in terms of the class profile, so we introduce it next. This class
29 is distinguished by an exceptionally high WTP in the lowest range segment: \$38.7k per 100 miles for the 40–130
30 mile range (***), declining to \$20.8k*** (130–200 miles) and \$25.5k*** (200+ miles). This pattern suggests a
31 disproportionate premium on crossing a minimum range viability threshold, with diminishing but still substantial
32 marginal returns at higher range levels. Their current primary vehicle have the highest range among all classes (321.3
33 miles), which partially explains their high WTP. Range loss aversion is moderate and significant across all segments
34 (\$0.9k***, \$0.7k***, \$0.5k***), while refurbishment WTPs are negligible and insignificant.

35 Class 3 represents the most EV-ready segment in the sample. They hold the most positive attitudes towards
36 refurbished EV batteries (65.5% agree they are environmentally positive; 35.5% disagree they are functionally
37 negative). They have lowest share of ICEV-only household (74.1%) and are most likely to prefer a car over an SUV

(57.2%). They have the highest electrical outlet access (57.5%). These active indicators mentioned above are all statistically significantly different from Class 1 in the model.

These respondents have the highest knowledge on EVs (81.1%) and related subsidy (31.9%). In addition, this group appears to be more risk-taking (39.0%), and with highest social status with the highest household income (\$97.1k), highest education attainment (58.5% bachelor or above), highest employment rate (71.5%).

Class 2: Degradation sensitive, Refurbishment-Averse ($n=661, 22.7\%$). Class 2 is the largest class, which is uniquely defined by high degradation sensitivity. Their disutility of range loss is strongest among all classes and uniform around \$2.3k*** per percentage across all three degradation segments. Their marginal returns on range is consistent across the first two piecewise segments and only significant at 90% significance, but slightly increasing at the highest level with higher statistical significance (\$4.6k for 40–130 miles, \$4.6k for 130–200 miles, and \$5.3k** for 200+ miles). Both refurbishment types generate meaningful disutility (\$2.7k* pack, \$3.8k** cell replacement). This could attribute to their relatively high concerns about the functionality of refurbished EV batteries: only 23.1% disagree that they are functionally negative, which is noticeably lower than Class 3 (35.5%).

Members of Class 2 have an average household income of \$91.3k, are relatively young (36.5 years), demonstrate high EV knowledge (76.2%), and above-average electrical outlet access (46.0%). Approximately 43.5% report a neighbor who owns or leases a BEV or PHEV. They also show high preference for SUVs at their next vehicle choice, which usually prefer to have longer lifespan.

This class represents well-informed consumers whose used-BEV valuations are highly responsive to signals. They are not particularly buying range — they are buying for battery reliability in the first place and also buying for protection against losing it in the long run.

Class 5: Range-and-Battery Sensitive ($n=606, 20.8\%$) Class 5 displays a distinctive opt-out pattern: only 5.2% never opt out, with the plurality opting out two (29.0%) or three (27.2%) times out of six tasks. This distribution is consistent with selective opt-out behavior, in which respondents choose the non-choice option only when presented alternatives fall below their attribute thresholds.

This class exhibits comprehensive and significant preferences across all levels of vehicle attributes, attending simultaneously to range maintenance, degradation trajectory, and refurbishment history when evaluating a used BEV. Range WTPs are consistent and substantial across all three segments, which diminishing returns after reaching minimal threshold (\$11.8k***, \$9.5k***, \$9.5k***). Range loss aversion is uniformly significant at \$0.8k*** per percentage point across at first two degradation levels and reduce to half at the highest level (0.4k*). Refurbishment disutility is the much higher (\$5.8k*** pack, \$6.1k*** cell replacement) than Class 2 and Class 3. Class 5 members have average incomes (\$86.9k), moderate range anxiety (83.4%), which help explain their acceptance for lower range options.

Class 6: Price-Sensitive, Low WTP (12.8%, $n=373$). Class 6 has the largest price coefficient in absolute value ($-4.017***$), more than twice the magnitude of the next-most price-sensitive class. As a result, they show the lowest WTP for all vehicle attributes. Range WTPs are statistically significant at lower range segments (\$2.8k** for 40–130 miles, \$1.8k* for 130–200 miles), and range loss aversion is marginal (\$0.2k** and \$0.2k*** across the upper degradation segments). Refurbishment WTPs are negligible.

Class 6 members have the lowest average household income (\$70.0k) and the lowest next-vehicle budget (\$19.7k). They have the lowest share of housing owners (43.0%), yet the highest share of apartment dwellers (48.8%). They have the lowest household ownership rate (1.9) and dominantly ICEVs (87.1%). These respondents consistently engage with the choice experiment and demonstrate a clear preference for vehicle acquisition, but their WTP profile is dominated by price rather than battery-specific attributes.

Class 4: Price-Insensitive, Refurbishment-Averse ($n=539, 18.5\%$). Class 4 is characterized by the smallest price coefficient in absolute value ($-0.144**$), indicating substantially lower price sensitivity than all other classes. Despite this, Class 4 exhibits the largest disutility for battery refurbishment: \$26.6k** for pack replacement and \$32.6k** for cell replacement. The strong preference against the no-choice option (\$242.4k**) is the highest in magnitude across all classes, and the class-specific alternative-specific constant is the largest (2.641***), reflecting a strong baseline preference for any BEV over the outside option. Class 4 has the highest shares of current BEV household ownership (13.5%), PHEV or HEV ownership (25.3%), and neighbors who own EVs (50.9%), alongside the lowest range anxiety (67.0%), the highest risk-taking propensity (51.9%), and the highest next-vehicle budget (\$29.3k). These respondents are committed EV adopters who, having already overcome price and range barriers, place an unusually high premium on a pristine battery service history.

Table 4
LCCM model results

	Class 1	Class 2	Class 3	Class 4	Class 5	Class 6
Vehicle Attributes						
No-Choice Option (opt-out)	-2.577 (1.344).	-9.819 (0.813)***	-1.968 (0.75)**	-3.491 (0.457)***	-2.513 (0.387)***	-13.847 (1.661)***
Mileage (10,000 miles)	-0.472 (0.248).	-0.3 (0.041)***	-0.31 (0.058)***	-0.143 (0.03)***	-0.22 (0.031)***	-0.229 (0.055)***
BEV Electric Range (Year 3): <130 miles	0.114 (1.326)	0.468 (0.281).	5.742 (0.417)***	0.177 (0.225)	1.426 (0.365)***	1.128 (0.399)**
BEV Electric Range (Year 3): 130-200 miles	1.884 (1.383)	0.472 (0.245).	3.089 (0.471)***	-0.145 (0.176)	1.14 (0.22)***	0.707 (0.357)*
BEV Electric Range (Year 3): 200+ miles	1.347 (0.61)*	0.545 (0.189)**	3.78 (0.733)***	0.198 (0.116).	1.145 (0.166)***	0.794 (0.507)
Range Loss Rate: <12%	-0.237 (0.072)***	-0.236 (0.029)***	-0.129 (0.024)***	0.004 (0.015)	-0.093 (0.017)***	-0.084 (0.03)**
Range Loss Rate: 12%-24%	-0.044 (0.063)	-0.239 (0.019)***	-0.102 (0.016)***	-0.018 (0.01).	-0.091 (0.013)***	-0.069 (0.02)***
Range Loss Rate: 24%+	0.035 (0.087)	-0.22 (0.03)***	-0.069 (0.019)***	-0.02 (0.01)*	-0.047 (0.019)*	-0.067 (0.02)***
Battery Refurbishment: Pack Replace	-0.932 (0.431)*	-0.281 (0.126)*	-0.08 (0.159)	-0.384 (0.105)***	-0.695 (0.106)***	0.041 (0.166)
Battery Refurbishment: Cell Replace	-1.074 (0.417)*	-0.385 (0.127)**	-0.099 (0.145)	-0.47 (0.102)***	-0.732 (0.11)***	0.109 (0.165)
Purchase Price (10,000 USD)	-1.467 (0.652)*	-1.025 (0.118)***	-1.484 (0.287)***	-0.144 (0.054)**	-1.206 (0.1)***	-4.017 (0.363)***
Active Indicators						
ASC	0	0.867 (0.5).	-0.272 (0.552)	2.641 (0.493)***	1.379 (0.539)*	1.28 (0.577)*
Perceived EV Range Anxiety: Agree	0	-0.021 (0.257)	-0.131 (0.272)	-0.734 (0.251)**	-0.118 (0.269)	-0.513 (0.283).
Risk Taking Propensity: Agree	0	0.692 (0.2)***	0.387 (0.214).	0.893 (0.204)***	0.042 (0.207)	0.001 (0.242)
Household Income (10,000 USD)	0	0.011 (0.016)	0.021 (0.018)	0.003 (0.017)	0 (0.018)	-0.048 (0.022)*
Electrical Outlet Access	0	0.391 (0.191)*	0.812 (0.205)***	0.525 (0.197)**	0.305 (0.195)	0.423 (0.223).
EV Battery Knowledge: Yes	0	0.146 (0.194)	0.307 (0.225)	-0.183 (0.202)	0.284 (0.197)	0.009 (0.223)
EV Battery Environmentally Positive: Agree	0	1.209 (0.189)***	1.295 (0.211)***	0.808 (0.196)***	0.829 (0.191)***	1.186 (0.217)***
EV Battery Functionally Negative: Disagree	0	0.987 (0.278)***	1.547 (0.284)***	0.822 (0.288)**	0.745 (0.29)*	1.169 (0.303)***
Current Primary Household Vehicle Fuel Type: ICEV	0	-0.629 (0.268)*	-0.592 (0.279)*	-1.227 (0.261)***	-0.596 (0.268)*	-0.015 (0.332)
Current Primary Vehicle Typical Range (miles)	0	-0.173 (0.091).	0.076 (0.098)	-0.325 (0.094)***	-0.113 (0.096)	-0.186 (0.101).
SUV/Crossover as the Next Vehicle	0	-0.203 (0.191)	-0.984 (0.273)***	-0.52 (0.198)**	-0.531 (0.191)**	-0.736 (0.222)***

Est. (SE)[Sig.]

Signif. codes: 0 '***' 0.001 '**' 0.01 '*' 0.05 '.' 0.1.

Table 5
WTP and Characteristics by Class

	Class 1 (n=252, 8.7%)	Class 2 (n=661, 22.7%)	Class 3 (n=485, 16.6%)	Class 4 (n=539, 18.5%)	Class 5 (n=606, 20.8%)	Class 6 (n=373, 12.8%)
WTP (*1000 USD) for Vehicle Attributes						
No-Choice Option (opt-out)	-\$17.6.	-\$95.8***	-\$13.3**	-\$242.4**	-\$20.8***	-\$34.5***
Mileage (10,000 miles)	-\$3.2.	-\$2.9***	-\$2.1***	-\$10.0**	-\$1.8***	-\$0.6***
BEV Range: 40-130 mi segment (per 100 miles)	\$0.8	\$4.6.	\$38.7***	\$12.3	\$11.8***	\$2.8**
BEV Range: 130-200 mi segment (per 100 miles)	\$12.8	\$4.6.	\$20.8***	-\$10.1	\$9.5***	\$1.8*
BEV Range: 200+ mi segment (per 100 miles)	\$9.2*	\$5.3**	\$25.5***	\$13.8.	\$9.5***	\$2.0
Range Loss Rate: 5-12% (per %)	-\$1.6*	-\$2.3***	-\$0.9***	\$0.3	-\$0.8***	-\$0.2**
Range Loss Rate: 12-24% (per %)	-\$0.3	-\$2.3***	-\$0.7***	-\$1.3.	-\$0.8***	-\$0.2***

Table 5
WTP and Characteristics by Class (*continued*)

	Class 1 (n=252, 8.7%)	Class 2 (n=661, 22.7%)	Class 3 (n=485, 16.6%)	Class 4 (n=539, 18.5%)	Class 5 (n=606, 20.8%)	Class 6 (n=373, 12.8%)
Range Loss Rate: 24%+ (per %)	\$0.2	-\$2.1***	-\$0.5***	-\$1.4*	-\$0.4*	-\$0.2***
Battery Refurbishment: Pack Replace	-\$6.4*	-\$2.7*	-\$0.5	-\$26.6**	-\$5.8***	\$0.1
Battery Refurbishment: Cell Replace	-\$7.3*	-\$3.8**	-\$0.7	-\$32.6**	-\$6.1***	\$0.3
Active Indicators						
Risk-taking Propensity: Agree: no	76.0%	56.0%	61.0%	48.1%	71.3%	72.4%
Risk-taking Propensity: Agree: yes	24.0%	44.0%	39.0%	51.9%	28.7%	27.6%
Perceived EV Range Anxiety: Agree: no	12.8%	17.0%	19.4%	33.0%	16.6%	22.0%
Perceived EV Range Anxiety: Agree: yes	87.2%	83.0%	80.6%	67.0%	83.4%	78.0%
EV Battery Environmentally Positive: Agree: no	69.5%	37.4%	34.5%	46.4%	47.7%	39.6%
EV Battery Environmentally Positive: Agree: yes	30.5%	62.6%	65.5%	53.6%	52.3%	60.4%
EV Battery Functionally Negative: Disagree: no	90.9%	76.9%	64.5%	78.5%	81.2%	72.1%
EV Battery Functionally Negative: Disagree: yes	9.1%	23.1%	35.5%	21.5%	18.8%	27.9%
Household Income (1000 USD)	85.5	91.3	97.1	89.3	86.9	70.0
EV Knowledge: no	31.5%	23.8%	18.9%	28.4%	23.5%	30.7%
EV Knowledge: yes	68.5%	76.2%	81.1%	71.6%	76.5%	69.3%
Electrical Outlet Access: no	63.0%	47.8%	37.2%	42.3%	51.8%	52.3%
Electrical Outlet Access: not_sure	4.1%	6.3%	5.3%	5.8%	6.4%	7.8%
Electrical Outlet Access: yes	32.8%	46.0%	57.5%	51.9%	41.8%	39.8%
Primary Vehicle Typical Range (miles)	306.8	292.2	321.3	267.6	297.4	282.2
Household Vehicle Fuel Composition: has_bev	1.7%	7.5%	9.2%	13.5%	7.5%	3.4%
Household Vehicle Fuel Composition: has_phev_hev	7.6%	16.1%	16.6%	25.3%	13.3%	9.5%
Household Vehicle Fuel Composition: icev_only	89.3%	76.2%	74.1%	61.2%	79.0%	87.1%
Household Vehicle Fuel Composition: other	1.4%	0.1%	0.0%	0.0%	0.2%	0.0%
Next Vehicle Type: SUV: no	31.8%	38.9%	57.2%	48.3%	46.3%	53.3%
Next Vehicle Type: SUV: yes	68.2%	61.1%	42.8%	51.7%	53.7%	46.7%
Inactive Indicators						
EV Subsidy Knowledge: no	89.4%	73.6%	68.1%	70.9%	78.0%	79.1%
EV Subsidy Knowledge: yes	10.6%	26.4%	31.9%	29.1%	22.0%	20.9%
Neighbor Owns/Leases a BEV/PHEV: no	46.9%	29.6%	26.0%	28.5%	31.8%	33.9%
Neighbor Owns/Leases a BEV/PHEV: not_sure	28.3%	26.9%	26.8%	20.6%	30.3%	31.2%
Neighbor Owns/Leases a BEV/PHEV: yes	24.7%	43.5%	47.2%	50.9%	37.9%	34.9%
Age	47.1	36.5	37.5	37.4	40.9	37.7
Gender: female	67.3%	65.1%	52.6%	57.9%	63.1%	60.1%
Gender: male	31.3%	32.7%	44.9%	41.3%	34.4%	36.0%
Gender: other	1.4%	1.9%	2.5%	0.8%	2.5%	3.2%
Gender: prefer_not_answer	0.0%	0.3%	0.0%	0.1%	0.0%	0.7%
Ethnicity: hispanic	5.3%	11.6%	9.8%	15.5%	11.5%	11.6%
Ethnicity: non-hispanic	94.7%	88.4%	90.2%	84.5%	88.5%	88.4%
Race: african_american_only	7.1%	17.9%	14.4%	22.3%	11.4%	11.7%
Race: other	10.4%	15.6%	14.5%	18.5%	18.1%	15.9%
Race: white_only	82.5%	66.5%	71.2%	59.2%	70.5%	72.4%
Education Level: bachelor	31.9%	36.8%	38.4%	32.9%	36.1%	31.7%
Education Level: graduate	17.0%	20.2%	20.4%	20.4%	19.6%	17.9%
Education Level: high_school	18.6%	12.6%	11.9%	16.8%	11.4%	16.0%
Education Level: prefer_not_answer	0.0%	0.2%	0.0%	0.1%	0.5%	0.5%
Education Level: some_college	32.6%	30.2%	29.3%	29.8%	32.4%	33.9%
Student Status: non-student	92.4%	84.1%	84.6%	84.0%	86.0%	80.6%
Student Status: prefer_not_answer	0.7%	1.1%	0.8%	0.9%	1.8%	1.9%
Student Status: student	6.9%	14.8%	14.6%	15.1%	12.1%	17.5%
Employment Status: full_time	38.2%	47.2%	48.4%	46.9%	43.1%	38.6%
Employment Status: not_employed	36.5%	26.0%	27.7%	29.4%	33.1%	33.5%
Employment Status: part_time	24.6%	25.7%	23.1%	22.8%	21.9%	26.1%
Employment Status: prefer_not_answer	0.7%	1.1%	0.8%	0.9%	1.8%	1.9%
Household Size	2.8	3.1	2.9	3.3	2.9	2.8
Household Tenure: other	6.1%	6.1%	5.8%	4.7%	4.9%	7.2%
Household Tenure: own	58.3%	49.6%	54.4%	49.5%	52.5%	43.0%

Table 5
WTP and Characteristics by Class (*continued*)

	Class 1 (n=252, 8.7%)	Class 2 (n=661, 22.7%)	Class 3 (n=485, 16.6%)	Class 4 (n=539, 18.5%)	Class 5 (n=606, 20.8%)	Class 6 (n=373, 12.8%)
Household Tenure: prefer_not_answer	1.6%	1.2%	1.8%	1.8%	1.6%	1.0%
Household Tenure: rent	34.1%	43.0%	38.1%	43.9%	41.0%	48.8%
Household Type: apart	17.2%	24.1%	21.6%	26.8%	21.9%	27.6%
Household Type: other	4.7%	3.2%	3.1%	3.2%	4.1%	3.9%
Household Type: sf_attached	9.2%	11.9%	9.2%	12.4%	10.6%	10.3%
Household Type: sf_detached	68.9%	60.9%	66.0%	57.6%	63.5%	58.2%
Household Vehicle Count	2.0	2.1	2.1	2.1	2.0	1.9
Primary Vehicle Fuel Type: bev	0.9%	3.1%	4.7%	6.1%	4.3%	1.4%
Primary Vehicle Fuel Type: icev	93.3%	85.3%	84.9%	72.0%	87.4%	91.6%
Primary Vehicle Fuel Type: phev_hev	5.8%	11.6%	10.4%	21.9%	8.3%	6.9%
Next Vehicle Budget (1000 USD)	24.3	27.8	26.9	29.3	25.2	19.7
Likelihood of buying used BEV: neutral	5.5%	12.6%	13.2%	16.7%	12.3%	13.6%
Likelihood of buying used BEV: somewhat_agree	6.3%	26.2%	26.2%	26.7%	18.9%	23.4%
Likelihood of buying used BEV: somewhat_disagree	14.7%	20.5%	24.1%	18.0%	19.7%	22.0%
Likelihood of buying used BEV: strongly_agree	3.2%	10.5%	10.1%	11.1%	8.0%	7.5%
Likelihood of buying used BEV: strongly_disagree	70.4%	30.2%	26.4%	27.6%	41.2%	33.5%
Climate Concern: no	78.3%	56.5%	57.6%	62.4%	59.8%	58.4%
Climate Concern: yes	21.7%	43.5%	42.4%	37.6%	40.2%	41.6%

Table 6
Metadata Summary by Class

	Class 1 (n=252, 8.7%)	Class 2 (n=661, 22.7%)	Class 3 (n=485, 16.6%)	Class 4 (n=539, 18.5%)	Class 5 (n=606, 20.8%)	Class 6 (n=373, 12.8%)
Metadata: Information Treatment						
Battery Information Treatment: no	51.6%	49.3%	50.7%	47.3%	48.3%	50.3%
Battery Information Treatment: yes	48.4%	50.7%	49.3%	52.7%	51.7%	49.7%
Metadata: Opt-out Count						
Opt-out: 0 times	0.0%	86.4%	85.7%	85.0%	5.2%	91.2%
Opt-out: 1 time	0.0%	12.0%	10.7%	12.2%	18.6%	7.4%
Opt-out: 2 times	0.0%	1.6%	2.9%	2.7%	29.0%	1.1%
Opt-out: 3 times	0.4%	0.1%	0.6%	0.1%	27.2%	0.3%
Opt-out: 4 times	4.8%	0.0%	0.0%	0.0%	15.3%	0.0%
Opt-out: 5 times	19.4%	0.0%	0.0%	0.0%	4.1%	0.0%
Opt-out: 6 times	75.4%	0.0%	0.0%	0.0%	0.6%	0.0%
Metadata: Survey Duration						
Battery DCE Section: Q1	22.0	24.0	26.0	19.0	26.0	24.0
Battery DCE Section: Q2	9.0	15.0	16.0	12.0	16.0	14.0
Battery DCE Section: Q3	7.0	13.0	15.0	11.0	13.0	12.0
Battery DCE Section: Q4	7.0	12.0	14.0	10.0	12.0	12.0
Battery DCE Section: Q5	6.0	12.0	13.0	9.0	12.0	11.0
Battery DCE Section: Q6	5.0	11.0	12.0	9.0	11.0	11.0
Battery DCE Section: Total	63.0	97.0	105.0	81.0	99.0	93.0
Full Survey	884.0	905.0	897.0	880.0	876.0	815.0



Figure 4: WTP and class profile summary.

1 **5.3. Results of Opt-out Analysis**

2 Among those who opted out of all six choice experiments, we explicitly asked them to explain the reasons why
3 they did not choose any of the used BEV options. Through a thematic analysis,

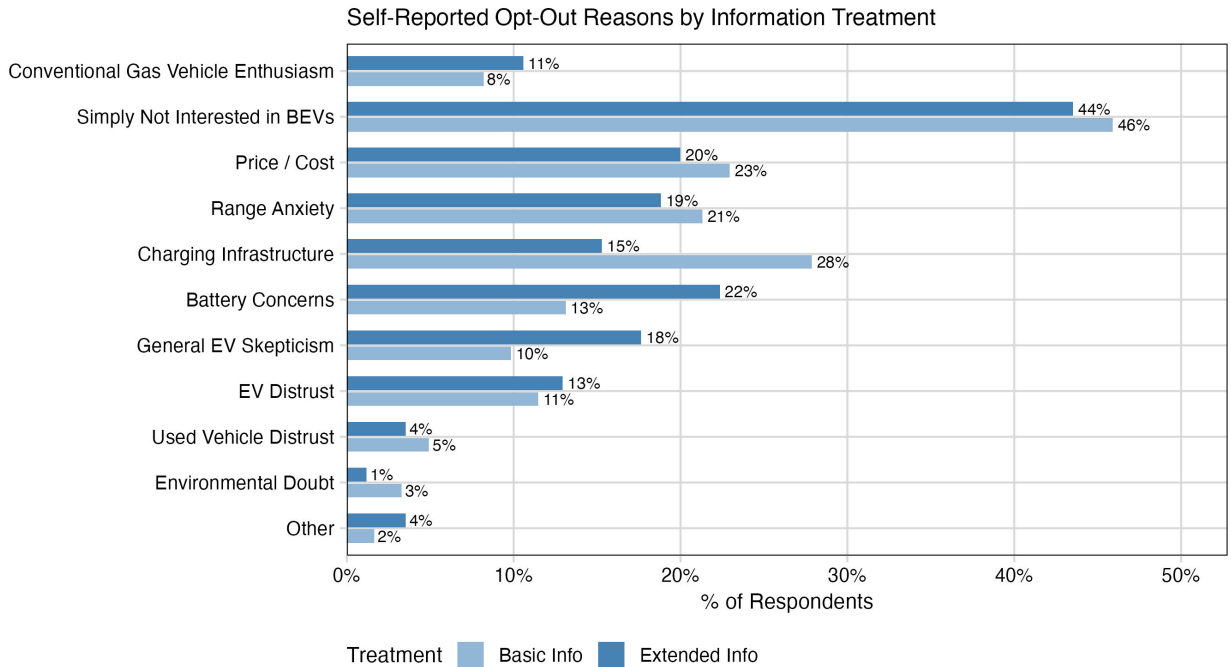


Figure 5: Six-class latent class model: class profiles.

4 **6. Conclusion**

5 As more EVs reach the end of their first ownership cycle, understanding the dynamics of the used EV market,
6 particularly the unique concerns surrounding battery condition, has become both timely and essential. Yet the
7 lack of transparent, standardized battery health information at the point of sale continues to fuel uncertainty and
8 undervaluation, which may impact adoption of pre-owned EVs. This DCI provides guidelines to survey design and data
9 collection effort that could address a major gap in the literature by focusing on how consumers evaluate used battery
10 electric vehicles (BEVs), what factors influence their willingness to adopt them, and how information asymmetries,
11 particularly around battery health, impact market confidence and transaction outcomes.

12 This survey-based study represents a novel and rigorous approach to addressing these challenges. By combining
13 insights from prior literature with a discrete choice experiment (DCE), the survey design allows researchers to
14 empirically estimate the value consumers place on different forms of battery information and vehicle characteristics.
15 Looking ahead, this DCI and the results from this research project can help shape the next phase of research and
16 innovation in the second-life EV battery space. For example, further studies could explore consumer attitudes toward
17 more complex refurbishment scenarios, such as partial vs. full battery replacements, and investigate how different
18 warranty structures influence willingness to pay. Additionally, integrating insights from behavioral economics and
19 data from telematics or vehicle diagnostics could enhance our understanding of how consumers interpret and act upon
20 battery health information.

21 Latent class heterogeneity is driven by BEV aversion (the extent to which they reject BEVs at purchase) and
22 disutility of battery degradation. Range anxiety are universal, including initial capacity and long-run loss. Battery cell-
23 level and pack-level refurbishments are valued similarly despite their technical differences, implying limited consumer
24 understanding.

CRediT authorship contribution statement

Xiatian Iogansen: Conceptualization, Data curation, Methodology, Software, Formal analysis, Writing - Original Draft, Writing - Review & Editing. **Zain hoda:** Conceptualization, Data curation, Methodology, Writing - Review & Editing. **Christina Gore:** Conceptualization, Data curation, Methodology, Investigation, Writing - Original draft preparation, Writing - Review & Editing, Supervision, Project administration, Funding acquisition. **Joshua D. Kneifel:** Conceptualization, Data curation, Methodology, Investigation, Writing - Review & Editing, Supervision, Project administration, Funding acquisition. **Sindhu Ranganath:** Data curation, Writing - Original Draft, Writing - Review & Editing. **John Helveston:** Conceptualization, Methodology, Writing - Review & Editing, Supervision.

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